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MUHAMMAD HAMZA KHALIL

SOC101 FINAL NOTES

Lesson 23
THEORIES OF SOCIAL CLASS AND STRATIFICATION – II

Max Weber (1864-1920) built his approach to stratification on the analysis developed by Marx, but he modified and elaborated it. **Like Marx, Weber regarded society as characterized by conflicts over power and resources**. Yet where Marx saw polarized class relations and economic issues at the heart of all conflict, Weber developed a more complex, multidimensional view of society.

According to Weber social stratification is a matter of

- Class
- Status
  Power

According to Weber **class divisions derive not only from control or lack of control of the means of production, but from economic differences**, which have nothing directly to do with property. Such resources include especially the **skills and credentials, or qualifications, which affect the types of job people, are able to obtain**.

Class

Weber believed that an individual's *market position* strongly influences his or her 'life chances'. **The market positions (capacities) people have in terms of the skills they bring to the labor market as employees, explains the rewards they will receive**. Where people have good market capacity they will have very good *life chances:* these chances include income, perks, and pensions together with less tangible benefits such as security of job, pleasant working environment and considerable autonomy at work. Those in managerial or professional occupations earn more, and have more favorable conditions of work, for example, than people in blue-collar jobs. The qualifications they possess, such as degrees, diplomas and

the skills they have acquired, make them more 'marketable' than others without such qualifications. Managers of corporations *control* the means of production although they do not *own* them. If managers can control property for their own benefit – awarding themselves huge bonuses and magnificent perks – it makes no practical difference that they do not own the property that they so generously use for their own benefit.

Status

Weber's theory refers to differences between social groups in the social honor or prestige they are accorded by others. **Presently status is being expressed through people's *styles of life*. Markers and symbols of status—such as housing, dress, manner of speech, occupation – all help to shape an individual's social standing in the eyes of others**. People sharing the same status form a community in which there is a sense of shared identity. Weber argued that status often varies independently of class divisions. Possession of wealth normally tends to confer high status, but there are many exceptions. Olympic gold medalists, for example, may not own property, yet they may have very high prestige. **Property and prestige is not one way street:**
Although property can bring prestige, prestige can also bring property.

Power

The third element of social class, is the ability to control others, even against their wishes.
Weber agreed with Marx that property is a major source of power, but he added that it is not the only source. With time, industrial societies witness the growth of the bureaucratic state. This expansion of government and other types of formal organizations means that power gains importance in the stratification system.
Party formation is an important aspect of power, and can influence stratification independently of
class and status. Party defines a group of individuals who work together because they have common backgrounds, aims or interests. **Party can be influenced by class but can also influence the economic circumstance of party members and thereby their class. Party membership cuts across class differences. There are parties based on religious affiliations and nationalist ideals and may include the 'haves' and 'have-nots'**. There could also be groups possessing effective political power without economic leverage (military, trade union). Therefore inequality could there due to political power.
In Weberian perspective society can be divided in 2+ classes as below:

Upper class	UPPER CLASS
Upper middle class	MIDDLE CLASS

Middle-middle class Lower middle class	
Skilled manual workers Semi-skilled workers. Unskilled manual workers.	WORKING CLASS
The poor	THE POOR

Weber's theory comes closer to explaining the dynamics of stratification in modern societies.
Weber anticipated the proliferation of classes, with a new class of white-collar employees, administrators, technicians and civil servants, who are growing in number and importance.
Property relations are important (Marx) but the market position and marketability is decisive in determining an individual's class position.
Weber rejected Marx's view that the workers (or employees) have nothing but their labor to sell to the highest bidder. The reality is that:

- Workers possess skills.
- The distribution of skills can be controlled (keep it scarce).
- Increase skill marketability.
-

Comparative picture of the conflict approach by Marx and Weber

MARX	WEBER
Relationship to means of production is all important	Focused more on the market position of those in employment.
Increasing polarity between classes and revolution	Growth of white-collar class that would mitigate against the collapse of capitalism
Class all embracing	Separate political status factors
fact of life	To come into play.

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Lesson 24
THEORIES OF CLASS AND SOCIAL STRATIFICATION – III

Why are societies stratified? One answer consistent with structural functional paradigm is that social inequality plays a vital part in the operation of society. This argument was put forth by Kingsley Davis and Wilbert Moor in 1945. ***The assertion is that social stratification has beneficial consequences for the operation of a society.*** That could be one explanation for the fact that some form of social stratification has been found everywhere.

Davis and Moore approach (1945) explain it like this:

- Some positions are functionally more important.
- Some roles can only be taken by certain individuals.
- High skills to be paid higher rewards.
- They have to be provided higher status.
- Stratification ensures that the most appropriate people are selected for high reward jobs.
- Meritocracy System is functional. To alter it is misguided.

i. **Criticism:**

- Why some positions are considered as functionally more important than others?
- Who decides what is important?
- Does meritocracy work? Does everybody get the same opportunities?

ii. Inequality is in-built in stratification.
iii. (Private schools. Status to be bought)
iv. Everybody does not achieve status (ascribed)

The wealthier a person becomes the lesser he/she needs to render any service to society.

Davis-Moore approach lacks empirical basis. (Evidence-based approach to the study and**).**

Lesson 25
SOCIAL CLASS AS SUBCULTURE

"**The language, beliefs, values, norms, behaviors, and the material objects that are possessed by people and are passed on from one generation to the next" is the usual definition of culture**.
Within the broad culture we also come across **subcultures where a group displays distinct patterns of behavior and the related values, norms, beliefs, and material possessions. These subcultures may relate to an ethnic group, an occupational group, an age group, and even to a social class**. Therefore, it can be assumed that each social class has a subculture with a system of behavior, a set of values, and a way of life.

The subculture of a social class serves to adapt people to the life style they lead and to prepare their children to assume their class status. **The passing of sub-cultural patterns of behavior and the related values and norms to the next generation takes place through the process of socialization**.

Notwithstanding with some overlapping and some exceptions, it remains true that the average middle class child has socialization very different from that of the average lower class child. Let us take just one aspect of socialization – those experiences that shape ambition, education, and work habits – and see how they differ between the two social class worlds.

Typical upper middle class children live in a class subculture where they are surrounded by educated persons who are ambitious, who go to work even when they don't feel like it, and who struggle to attain success. They are acquainted with the achievements of their ancestors, relatives, and friends.

It is normal for them to assume that they too are going to accomplish something in the world.
When they go to school they find its culture close to their family culture. The teacher speaks similar language, the material in the books is reflective of their culture, and there are many other aspects of the environment that are familiar to the child.
“Study hard so you can do well and become a success someday”, the advice given by the teachers makes sense. Their parents echo the same words; meanwhile they see people like themselves (brothers, sisters, relatives, acquaintances) who are actually completing educations and moving on into promising careers. For most of the middle class children, to grow up means to complete an advanced education and launch a career.
Lower class children grow up in a class subculture where scarcely any one is educated, and has a steady job for long. In their world meals are haphazard and irregular. They marry early in age and usually have large number of children. Many people sleep three or four in a bed. These children are often not in school and if they do go to school, they often go unwashed and unfed. In school they are likely to be disoriented by coming across people coming from middle class families (the students and the teachers). Very soon they conclude that the school is a prison. They learn little. The school often abandons any serious effort to teach them by branding them as “discipline problems”. They receive little reinforcement for paying attention to studies. Even in the environment many children may be out of school, either doing nothing or engaged in some work. For them school may not be a stepping-stone to a career. Since school does not motivate them to study so they drop out early. The horizon of ambitions seldom extends the next week.
The children in varying social classes grow up in a different human capital as well as cultural capital.
From growing up in a culture of poverty, the poor, in general, learn to accept their poverty. The poor expect failure, just as people born to affluence expect success. The expectation of failure can deprive the impoverished individuals of the confidence they need to spend their

human capital. The expectation of success encourages affluent individuals to maximize their human capital.

As part of the socialization process, social class penetrates our consciousness, shaping our ideas of life and our proper place in society. When the rich look around, they sense superiority and control over destiny. In contrast, the poor see defeat, and a buffeting by unpredictable forces. People tend to see the effects of social class on their lives. One consequence of facing emergency after emergency and not having enough resources to meet them – ***and seeing the future as more of the same* – is the lack of, deferred gratification, giving up things in the present for the** sake **of greater gains in the future**. It is difficult to practice this middle class virtue if one does not have the surplus it requires. Any savings are gobbled up by the emergencies faced by the poor, so any saving for future was fruitless. The only thing that made sense from this perspective was to enjoy what they could at the moment. Immediate gratification was not the cause of their poverty, but its consequence. Cause and consequence loop together, for their immediate gratification, in turn, helped perpetuate their poverty.

Culture of poverty (concept given by Oscar Lewis in mid-sixties) assumes that the values and behaviors of the poor make them fundamentally different from other people that these factors largely are responsible for their poverty, and that parents perpetuate poverty across generations by passing these characteristics to their children. Poor form a subculture in which, as a result of their common experiences, **they have developed certain attitudes and behavior patterns which have been transmitted from parent to child.**

Critics of culture of poverty argue that the "**expecting to fail**" argument amount to blaming the victim. By blaming the poor for their own poverty, culture of poverty theories divert attention from the social, structural and cultural conditions that are ultimately responsible for poverty. Critics claim that the poor, in general tend to be as success-oriented as the affluent, if not for them then for their children. **The**

difference between the poor and the affluent, therefore, lies mainly in their relative access to educational and occupational opportunities to demonstrate their human capital.

Look at you: Do culture of poverty / culture of affluence theories apply to any of the ways in which you have been advantaged or disadvantaged in your life choices and the life chances? To what extent has your social class background led you to expect success or to expect failure?

Lesson 26

SOCIAL MOBILITY

Social mobility is an act of moving from one social class to another. The amount of movement up and down the class structure would indicate the extent of social mobility prevalent in the society. **The social mobility is greatly influenced by the level of openness of the society**. Open society is the one where people attain their status primarily by their own efforts. In fact the extent of mobility may be taken as an index of openness of a society indicating how far talented individuals born into lower strata can move up the socioeconomic ladder. In this respect, social mobility is an important political issue, particularly in countries committed to liberal vision of equality of opportunity to all citizens. In this perspective industrial societies are mostly open societies portraying high social mobility. Compared with them, pre-industrial societies have mostly been found to be closed societies where there has been low social mobility. People in such societies have been confined to their ancestral occupations and their social status has mostly been ascribed.

Social mobility can be classified as:

Vertical mobility: The movement of individuals and **groups up or down the socioeconomic scale**. Those who gain in property, income,

status, and position are said to be upwardly mobile, while those who move in the opposite direction are downwardly mobile.

Horizontal mobility: The movement of individuals and groups **in similar socioeconomic positions, which may be in different work situations**. This may involve change in occupation or remaining in the same occupation but in a different organization, or may be in the same organization but at a different location.

Lateral mobility: It is a geographical **movement between neighborhoods**, towns or regions. In modern societies there is a great deal of geographical mobility.

Lateral mobility is often combined with vertical as well as horizontal mobility. The movement of people up or down the social hierarchy can be looked at either within one generation called intra-generational mobility or between generations labeled as inter-generational mobility.

Intra-generational mobility

It consists of movement up and down the stratification system by members of a single generation **(the-social class in which you began life compared with your social class at the end of your life).**

Inter-generational mobility

It consists of movement up and down the stratification system by members of successive generations of a family (**your social class location compared with that of your parents, for example**). Comparison is usually made between social class status of son and father.

Mobility is functional. Open societies provide opportunities to its members for the development of their talents and working toward their

individual fulfillment. At the same time a person can select the best person for doing a particular job.

Mobility determinants

Three main factors that affect mobility:

Structural factors:

Structural factors are the ones**, which determine the relative proportion of high-status positions to be filled and the ease of getting them.** Societies differ in the relative proportion of high- and low-status positions to be filled. A society with a primarily agricultural economy will have many low-status and few high-status positions, and mobility will be low. **The rate of mobility rises with the degree of industrialization of the economy**. In an industrial society there is expected to be an increase in the number of occupations as well as in the number of jobs in each occupation. An increase in the division of labor is expected and along with it there is increasing specialization, hence the jobs multiply. As the societies move from agricultural to industrial and to post-industrial societies, there is a change in the nature of jobs e.g. decline in manufacturing jobs and an increase in service jobs. Such a change provides new opportunities for employment, which the people avail and thereby the whole process becomes instrumental to social mobility

Even in a relatively open society, upward mobility is not open equally to everyone. Middle class children typically have learning experiences which are more helpful in gaining upward mobility than the experiences of lower-class children. Nevertheless, mobility may further depend upon the prevalent policies, laws and other factors that may discriminate between groups and individuals on the basis of factors like race, gender, religion, age, and ethnicity.

Individual factors:

While structural factors may determine the proportion of high-status, well-paid positions in a society, individual factors greatly affect which persons get them. **It means that one has to look into the procedures of access and entry to the available positions**. There could be the possession of the entry based qualifications by the individuals and there could be number of individual factors that influence the possession of necessary qualifications.

The individuals may have differences in their "**mobility oriented behaviors**". There is much which persons can do to increase their prospects for upward mobility by improving their educational qualifications. The work habits learned in early childhood are very important for making efforts in improving one's position. Of course hard work carries no guarantee of upward mobility, but not many achieve upward mobility without it.

Then there is the often referred "**principle of deferred gratification."** This consists of postponing immediate satisfaction in order to gain some later goal. Saving one's money to go for higher studies or to start a business is an example. At the moment you are studying sociology rather than using the same time for having fun somewhere else. You are postponing 'having fun' over studying the subject of sociology. In this way you are practicing "deferred-gratification" pattern of behavior. The parents may spend the money on the education of their child and postpone the celebration of his marriage.

Mobility oriented people are likely to demonstrate such pattern of behavior. It is usually assumed that the "deferred gratification" principle is followed by the middle class people. **Gender differential** may be another factor as part of individual differences. It is generally observed

that there are greater opportunities for males than for females. Even if the two persons possess the same qualifications but being a male or a female may influence one's climbing the mobility ladder.

Under the law such a discriminatory approach may be prohibited but in reality it may be practiced in an invisible way. Such a barrier is usually referred to as **"Glass ceiling": a concept used to explain how women are prevented from attaining top (managerial and professional) jobs**. In **UK 50%** of daughters of professional and managerial households enter non-manual job (intermediate level) with little chance of work-life upward mobility.

Differential fertility by social class:

The number of suitable off-springs available to fill the positions from the same class is another factor influencing social mobility. **The inadequate number of children available in the middle class to fill jobs will provide an opportunity for the children from the adjacent class to fill the vacancies.**

Interaction of all factors:

All of the above factors interact and have a cumulative effect on the mobility of a person. Look at a person who is poor, uneducated, and belongs to a minority group is handicapped on all three counts and all these factors may interact and make things worse for him.

Costs:

While social mobility permits society to fill its occupational vacancies with the most able people and offers the individual a chance to attain his or her life goal, it also involves certain costs**. A mobile society arouses expectations which are not always fulfilled, thereby creating**

dissatisfaction and unhappiness. One could come across lot more frustrations in the mobile society than in the traditional society.

The costs could include fear of falling in status, as in downward mobility; the strain of new roles learning in occupational promotions, the disruption of primary group relationships as a person moves upward or downward. Parents and children may become strangers because of changes in social attitudes. Mobility oriented parents may work hard, come home late, and have less interaction with their children. It may lead to bitterness and estrangement.

Social mobility often demands geographic mobility, with a painful loss of treasured social ties. An offered promotion may be declined because of fear of the burden of new responsibilities. Even marriages may be threatened when spouses are not equally interested in mobility. It can result in mental illness and conflict.

General observations:

- Social mobility, at least among men, has been fairly high. Comparative mobility between men and women shows that **men have been more mobile than women**.
- The long-term trend in social mobility has been upward. With the shift toward industrial economies there are prospects of enhanced job opportunities resulting in **greater scope for upward mobility.**
- Within a single generation, social mobility is generally incremental, not dramatic. Most young families increase their income over time as they gain education and skills. But with the exception of few drastically upward or downward mobility cases, most **social mobility involves limited movement within one class level rather than striking moves between classes**

Lesson 27

THE FAMILY: GLOBAL VARIETY

The family is a social institution that unites individuals into cooperative groups that oversees the bearing and rearing of children. Marriage may be one of the important rituals that are instrumental in uniting individuals. Whereas the marriage and family appear to be universal there is a global variety in this institution. Let us look at some of the basic concepts related to family and marriage and see some global diversity in each.

Family: **A social group of two or more people, related by blood, marriage, or adoption who usually live together**. In other words it is a group of persons directly linked by kin connections, the adult members of which assume the responsibility for caring for children. This is a conventional definition of family. In the technologically advanced societies, today, some people object to defining only married couples and children as "families" because it implies that everyone should accept a single standard of moral conduct. More and more organizations are coming to recognize families of affinity, that is people with or without legal or blood ties who feel they belong together and wish to define themselves as a family.

Household: It consists of all people who occupy the same housing unit – a house, an apartment, or other living arrangement.

Kinship: A social bond, based on blood, marriage, or adoption that joins individuals into families. Connections between individuals established either through marriage or through lines of descent that connect blood relatives (parents, siblings, children, cousins, in-laws).

Nuclear family: Two married adults living together in a household with or without their children. This is also called a **conjugal family**.

Extended family: When close relatives other than a married couple and children live either in the same household or in a close and continuous relationship with one another. It may include grandparents, brothers and their wives, unmarried sisters, aunts, uncles, nephews, and cousins. It is also **called a consanguine family**.

Family of orientation: A family in which an individual grows up, usually born in it as well. This family is central to a child's socialization and orientation.

Family of procreation: Family formation by the individuals themselves. It is the family that you create through marriage or remarriage and then procreate as well. **This family is formed when a couple has their first child.**

Marriage Patterns

Marriage

Marriage is a legally sanctioned relationship of two or more people, usually involving economic cooperation as well as normative sexual activity and child-bearing that people expect to be enduring.
Marriage is the appropriate context for procreation that is how the concept of illegitimacy comes in. It is a socially approved mating arrangement – usually marked out by a ritual of some sort (wedding) indicating the couple's new public status. Cultural norms, as well as laws, identify people as suitable or unsuitable marriage partners. Incest taboos prohibit marriage between certain close relatives. Who is a close relative may vary from society to society. For example in Pakistan the

marriage between first cousins is allowed but in most of the industrialized societies it has prohibited by law.

Endogamy: The practice of mate selection from the same social category. It limits marriage prospects to others of the same age, race, religion, or social class.

Exogamy: The practice that mandates marriage between different social categories. It could imply an incest taboo, which could also be transformed into written law.

Monogamy: A form of marriage joining two partners. At a time the two partners are only in "one union". The two partners may divorce and enter into a new union at a time, which may be referred to as serial monogamy. This practice is mostly followed in technologically advanced societies.

Polygamy: A form of marriage uniting three or more people. It could take different forms of many unions. Polygamy exist in three specific forms, including

- **Polygyny:** A form of marriage uniting one male and two or more females. Islamic nations permit men up to four wives, though they have to fulfill certain conditions.
- **Polyandry:** A form of marriage uniting one female with two or more males. This pattern /.appears only rarely **(often quoted example of Tibet**).
- **Group marriage**: A group of men marrying a group of women. It is an odd situation.

RESIDENTIAL PATTREN

Patrilocal: A residential pattern in which a married couple lives with or near the husband's family.

Matrilocal: A residential pattern in which a married couple lives with or near the wife's family.

Neolocal: A residential pattern in which a married couple lives apart from the parents of both the spouses.

PATTERNS OF DESCENT

Descent refers to the system by which the members of a society trace kinship over generations. Most pre-industrial societies trace kinship through only one side of the family – the father or the mother. It is also an orderly way of passing property and other rights to the next generation.

Patrilineal: A system tracing kinship through males. Children are related to one another only through their fathers and fathers typically pass their property on to their sons. **It is mostly found in agrarian societies.**

Matrilineal: A system tracing kinship through women.

Bilateral: (two sided descent) A system tracing descent through both men and women. One may come across this system in industrial societies portraying gender equality.

PATTERNS OF AUTHORITY

Patriarchy: A system in which authority is vested in males; male control of a society or a group. This is the most prevalent system all over the world.

Matriarchy: Authority vested in females; female control of a society or group. True matriarchy rarely found in history.

Egalitarian: Authority more or less equally divided between people or groups (husband and wife). In reality patriarchy continues – typical bride takes the groom's last name; children are given the father's last name.

LESSON 28

FUNCTIONS OF FAMILY

Structural-Functionalists suggest that family performs several vital functions. In fact in this perspective **family has been considered as "The backbone of society**". At the same time the social conflict paradigm considers the family central to the operations of society, but rather than focusing on societal benefits, conflict theorists investigate how the family makes social inequality. The important functions are:

1. **Regulation of sexual activity**. Every culture regulates sexual activity in the interest of maintaining kinship organization and property rights. One universal regulation is the incest taboo (**A taboo that prohibits sexual relations between certain people in an individual's family, typically between those with a close blood (consanguinity) tie, a cultural norm forbidding sexual relations or marriage between certain kin).** Precisely which kin fall within the incest taboo varies from one culture to another. Mostly marriage with close relatives like parents, grandparents, aunts, uncles, siblings, is prohibited.

The incest taboo may have medical explanations as reproduction between close relatives of any species can mentally and physically impair off springs. Yet it has social reasons. First the incest taboo minimizes sexual competition within families by restricting legitimate sexuality to spouses. Second incest taboo forces people to marry

themselves outside their immediate families, which serve the purpose of integrating the larger society. Third, since kinship defines people's rights and obligations towards each other, reproduction among close relatives would hopelessly confuse kinship ties and threaten social order.

2. **Reproduction**. Perhaps the only function that seems to have been left to a great extent untouched is reproduction. Without reproduction the continuation of society is at stake and the legitimate births take place only within the wedlock. Yet even this vital and inviolable function has not gone unchallenged. A prime example is the number of single women in the Western society who have children (about one third of all births in US).

3. **Socialization of children**. The family is the first and most influential setting for socialization. Ideally the parents teach children to be well-integrated and participating members of society. In fact, family socialization continues throughout life cycle. Adults change within marriage, and, as any parent knows, mothers and fathers learn as much from raising their children as their children learn from them.

The **conflict sociologists try to find** fault with the outcome of this socialization through which there is likely **to be the transmission of cultural values**. There is the continuity of patriarchy, which subordinates women to men. Families therefore transform women into the sexual and economic property of men. Most wives' earnings belong to their husbands.

4. **Social placement**. Parents confer their own social identity – in terms of race, ethnicity, religion, and social class – on children at birth. This fact explains the long-standing preference for birth to

married parents. This is more like ascription of social status to the children,

Nevertheless, racial and ethnic categories shall persist over generations only to the degree that people marry others like themselves. Thus endogamous marriage shores up the racial and ethnic hierarchy of a society. Conflict sociologists traced the origin of the family to the need to identify heirs so that men (especially in the higher classes) could transmit property to their sons. Families thus support the concentration of wealth and reproduce the class structure in each succeeding generation. Therefore family plays an important function in maintaining social inequality; hence it is a part and parcel of capitalism.

5. **Care of the sick and elderly**. Family has been a big insurance against the old age as well as during sickness. As the society moves towards the industrialization this function is likely to be taken over by institutionalized medicine and medical specialists. Care of the aged is likely to change from a family concern to a government obligation. In Pakistani society, by and large, it remains to be an important function of the family.

6. **Protective function**. Family provides some degree of physical, economic, and psychological security to its members. Attack on a person is considered to be an attack on the family. Similarly guilt and shame are equally shared by the family. **People view the family as a "haven in the heartless world**", looking to kin for physical protection, emotional support, and financial assistance. People living in families tend to be healthier than living alone.

7. **Economic production.** Prior to industrialization, the family constituted an economic team. Family members cooperated in producing what they needed to survive. When industrialization moved production from home to factory, it disrupted this family team and weakened the bonds that tied family members together. In Pakistan family still performs an important function at least in helping its members in establishing their careers and obtaining jobs.

LESSON 29

FAMILY AND MARRIAGE IN TRANSITION

Pakistani society is certainly experiencing the changing trend toward industrial-urban way of life. Every third person in Pakistan is presently living in a locality, which has been declared as urban; thereby these urbanites are likely to experience diversities around. A variety of social and economic forces become instrumental in the erosion of traditional family and marriage values. We are trying to hold on to the sacred values of this institution, though we cannot ignore the secular inroads that are already taking place. Are these positive developments or are these threatening? **Nevertheless, the dramatic changes in the social norms and values have transformed the family life**. Therefore, let us look at some of the changes that are being experienced by the family and marriage nationally and internationally.

1. **Family is losing functions**. Except for procreation of children, for all other functions it traditional functions of the family. In the developed countries families have accepted such a take-over whereas in Pakistan such a change is fast coming. For example

educational institutions and mass media of communication are becoming powerful agents of socialization of children. Health care, matrimonial arrangements, maternal services, and many other family responsibilities are being taken over by professionals. We are heading towards a situation where right from the birth till our burial the whole of our life is likely to be handled by the professional functionaries.

2. **Families are exerting less influence over the lives of their members**. Modern society is an "**other directed" society where the behavior of a person is much influenced by the peer group (contemporaries) who is found outside of the family**. Of course the families try to have a control on the kinds of friends their children are likely to have but the variety of peers the children come across while out in school may be beyond the limits of families. Nevertheless, these very peer groups might become strengths for the socialization of children. Such a situation might be well experienced by the families where both the parents are working. Even these parents are likely to pick up many of their styles of life from outside.
3. **Shift toward nuclear/conjugal families**. As an outcome of empirical regularity, there is a postulated universality of nuclear family. As the traditional family systems break down, though with different speed, in industrial society hiring is on the basis of competency; efficiency is measured by individual performance; job market requires mobility; none of these requirements need strong kinship network. Industrializing societies create their other formal agencies to replace help from kinship networks. Individuals have independent careers, and "go their own way" ignoring extended kinship ties. Even in stress nuclear family appears to be quite responsive to provide emotional support.

4. **Kin networking fading and being replaced by friends networking.** People either depend on their own self or on their social capital of friends.
5. **Declining size of families**. With the societies moving towards modernization, there is a decline in the fertility of women. In Pakistan from 6.3 children per woman in the 1970 we have come down to around 4 children per woman in 2004. Some of the reasons could be: the rise in age at first marriage; decline in infant mortality (140/1000 live births in 1970 to around 85/1000 in 2004); increasing number of women especially older women not desiring to get pregnant and younger wanting to space births; decline in desired family size; use of contraceptives. All these reasons may have strong link with the education of families.
6. **The rise of symmetrical families**. There is an increase in dual earner families. One could find a trend in the families where both husband and wife are working and sharing the household work. Or if the wife is busy in the second shift at home, the husband might also be having a second job.
7. **Patriarchy on the decline**. As the proportion of dual earners marriages continues to increase, women's financial dependence on their husbands declines, leading to a decline in patriarchy. In the changing scenario instead of centralized decision making, families are moving towards shared decision making. Hence patriarchy gives way to egalitarianism.
8. **Arranged marriages are being replaced by 'marriages of inclination'**. Traditionally marriages of children were arranged by their parents, but now youngsters are trying to exert their personal choices in their matrimony.

9. **9Women empowerment**. There is a changing status of women due to increase in literacy and in the levels of literacy, financial independence, and in their decision making power.
10. **Divorce rates have been increasing**. There could be many reasons like:
    - Individualism on the increase. People are looking for personal happiness.
    - Romantic love often subsides. Marriages of inclination are relatively more vulnerable to conflict and divorce.
    - Women now are less dependent on men.
    - Many of today's marriages are stressful. Since both husband and wife are working, their jobs consume most of their time and energy, then, if they have to raise the children, there is not enough time and energy left for each other.
    - Presently divorce is becoming more socially accepted. It is no more considered a stigma.
    - From legal stand point, divorce is becoming easier to obtain. Couple may not have to resort to mud throwing on each other, so the couple decides and the court allows.
11. **Lone old parent families on the increase**. The institution of family as the shelter for the aged is gradually eroding. As the children grow up they, in search of their livelihood, head for new destinations leaving their senior citizens in the empty nest. Here one could find a big gap between the real and ideal value about caring the old people. Even the alternatives like the community support, nursing homes have not emerged. The plight of single women, widows, and the sick persons is high. We have added years to life but not life to added years.
12. **Awareness of family violence has increased**. May be in the changing situation family violence has also increased.

13. **The number of elderly marriages and remarriages is increasing**. The people deciding to get married in their old age don't feel shy anymore. Rather than leading a lonely life in case of their being divorced or widowed, the elderly decide to get married. Since divorce does not appear to be a stigma, therefore, divorcees don't feel hesitant to remarry.
14. **Monogamy presumably becoming universal**. There might be an increase in remarriages but the individuals are restricting themselves to one union at a time. So people marry, divorce, and remarry, but at time a person is married to **only one partner, which may be called as serial monogamy.**

Lesson 30
GENDER: A SOCIAL CONSTRUCTION

Sociologists use the term sex to refer to the anatomical and physiological differences that define male and female bodies. .

Gender, by contrast, concerns the psychological, social and cultural differences between males and females. Gender is linked to socially constructed notions of masculinity and femininity; it is not necessarily a direct product of an individual's biological sex. The distinction between sex and gender is a fundamental one, since many differences between males and females are not biological in origin.

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Three broad approaches to behavioral difference between men and women:

1. Biological basis.
2. Importance of socialization and the learning of gender roles.
3. Both gender and sex have no biological basis, but are entirely socially constructed.

Gender and biology: natural differences in behaviour

How far are the differences in the behavior of men and women the result of sex rather than gender? Some authors hold that aspects of human biology – ranging from hormones to chromosomes to brain size to genetics – are responsible for innate differences in behavior between men and women. Researches to identify the physiological origins of behavioral differences between men and women have been unsuccessful. The role of social interaction in shaping human behavior is vital.

Gender socialization

Through socialization, children gradually internalize the social norms and expectations, which are seen to correspond with their sex, hence differences in their behavior. **Therefore it is the society that determines the appropriateness of behavior relevant to male and female.** Also, through the process of socialization, the society makes a concerted effort that males and females internalize the culturally appropriate relevant patterns of behavior. Hence gender differences in behavior are not biologically determined, but they are culturally produced.

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Social construction of gender and sex

Both sex and gender are socially constructed products. Not only is gender a purely social creation that lacks a fixed 'essence', yet the human body itself is subject to social forces, which shape and alter it in various ways. **Individuals can choose to construct and reconstruct their bodies as they please- ranging from exercise, dieting, piercing and personal fashion, to plastic surgery and sex change operations. Human body and biology are not 'givens', but are subject to human urgency and personal choice within different social contexts. Genetic technology appears to have further facilitated the realization of socially desirable characteristics of males and females.**

The theorists who believe in the social construction of sex and gender reject all biological bases for gender differences. Gender identities emerge in relation to perceived sex differences in society and in turn help to shape those differences.

These approaches try to explain the gender difference in the behavior of men and women either in biology or in social construction. In reality it could also be possible that the gender differences in behavior may be placed on a continuum, **biological determinists** could hold one end of which and the other end could be held by **social constructionists.**

It is argued that every society has gender order, composed of a historically specific division of labour, and the structure of power. The gender order generates a variety of masculinities and of femininities. **Masculinities refer to various socially constructed collections of assumptions, expectations and ways of behaving that serve as standards for forms of male behavior.** Look at the word '*mardaangee'.* One could find colloquial substitutes in

different cultures. The process of indoctrination of the characteristics associated with '*manliness'* starts right from the childhood. **For example** take the little boy who got hurt and starts crying. He is told not to do so because crying is not considered an appropriate behavior for men. Femininities cover various socially constructed collections of assumptions, expectations and ways of behaving that serve as standards for female behavior. The mere fact that men and women across the societies are not characterized by identical behaviors is suggestive of the fact that these differences are not caused by biology but by socialization. Hence **masculinities** and **femininities** are subject to change across cultures and over time.

Global comparisons show that, by and large, societies do not consistently define most tasks as whether feminine or masculine. As societies industrialize, which gives people more choices and decreases the significance of muscle power, gender distinctions become smaller and smaller. Gender, then, is simply a too variable across cultures to be considered a simple expression of biology. Instead, as with many other elements of culture, what it means to be female and male is mostly a creation of society.

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LESSON 31
GENDER SOCIALIZATION

Gender socialization is the ways in which society sets children onto different courses in life because they are male or female**. Children are born with a biological difference i.e. given by nature, but gender differences are inculcated through nurturance**. It is the socialization process that lays the foundation of contrasting orientations to life that carries over from childhood into adulthood.

How do people learn that certain activities are "masculine" and others "feminine", and on that basis proper for them or not? Origins of such gender differences in behavior can be traced back to socialization where individuals learn how to play various roles in accordance to their cultural prescriptions. Gender ordering generates a variety of **masculinities** and **femininities.** Also the same gender order acts as a framework within which gender differences emerge and are reproduced or challenged. **Masculinities** refer to various socially constructed collections of assumptions, expectations and ways of behaving that serve as standards for forms of male behavior. **Femininities** include various socially constructed collections of assumptions, expectations and ways of behaving that serve as standards for female behavior.

Masculinity and femininity are subject to change not only across cultures, but also over time.

Feminine traits	**Masculine traits**
Submissive	Dominant
Dependent	Independent
Unintelligent/incapable	Intelligent/competent

Emotional	Rational
Receptive	Assertive
Weak	Strong
Timid	Brave
Content	Ambitious
Passive	Active
Cooperative	Competitive
Sensitive	Insensitive
Sex object	sexually aggressive

Role of family:

The first question people usually ask about a new-born – Is it a boy or girl? In fact, gender is at work even before the birth of child, since most parents in the world hope to have a boy than a girl. Soon after birth, family members usher infants into the "pink world" of girls or the "blue world" of boys. Parents even convey gender messages unconsciously in the way they handle daughters and sons, and thereby inculcate relevant traits by sex

.

Role of peer groups:

Peer groups further socialize their members in accordance with the normative conceptions of gender. Games differ by gender. Male games are usually competitive. Male peer activities reinforce masculine traits of aggression and control. Competitiveness for boys and cooperativeness for girls is the usual motto.

Role of schooling:

School curricula encourage children to embrace appropriate gender patterns.

Girls: Secretarial skills, home-cantered know-how.

Boys: Woodworking, auto-mechanics.

Colleges continue with the same pattern. Humanities for girls and hard subjects for boys. Gender images in textbooks.

Role of Mass Media:

The number of male characters is much higher than female characters. Also women are not featured in prominent roles.

Men generally play the brilliant detectives, fearless explorers, and skilled surgeons. Women by contrast, play the less capable characters, and are often important primarily, by their sexual attractiveness. Historically, ads have presented women in home, happily using cleaning products, serving food, trying out appliances, and modeling clothes. Magazine and newspapers: Pictures, activities, gestures. Advertising perpetuates “beauty myth”. Cosmetics and diet industry target women. The concept of “Beauty” is a social construct.

Society teaches women to measure themselves in terms of physical appearance: to be beautiful for whom and to attract whom, and how? Men want to possess the beauties as objects.

Gender Stratification

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Gender stratification refers to society's unequal distribution of wealth, power, and privilege between men and women.

For many years research on stratification was 'gender blind' – it was written as though women did not exist, or as though, for purposes of analyzing division of power, wealth and prestige women were unimportant and uninteresting. Yet gender itself is one of the profound examples of stratification. There are no societies in which men do not, in some aspect of social life, have more wealth, status, and influence than women.

How far we can understand gender inequalities in modern times mainly in terms of class divisions? Inequalities of gender are more deep rooted historically than class systems; men have superior standing to women even in hunting and gathering societies, where there are no classes. Class divisions in modern societies are so marked that there is no doubt that they 'overlap' substantially with gender inequalities. The material position of most women tends to reflect that of their fathers or husbands; hence it can be argued that we have to explain gender inequalities mainly in class terms.

Determining women's class position

The view that class inequalities largely govern gender stratification was often an unstated assumption until quite recently. The 'conventional position' in class analysis was that the paid work of women is relatively insignificant compared to that of men, and that therefore women can be regarded as being in the same class as their husbands. Since majority of women have traditionally been in a position of economic dependence on their husbands, it follows that their class position is most often governed by the husband's class situation.

This position has been criticized in many ways. **First, in many households the income of women is essential to maintaining the family's economic position and mode of life**. In these circumstances women's paid employment in some part determines the class position of the family as a whole. Second, a wife's occupation may sometimes set the standard of the family as a whole. Even if the woman earns less than her husband, her working situation may still be the 'lead' factor in influencing the class of her husband.

Third, where 'cross-class' households exist – in which the work of the husband is in a different class category from that of the wife – there may be some purposes for which it is more realistic to treat men and women, even within the same households, as being in different class positions. **Fourth, the proportion of households in which women are sole breadwinners is increasing.** The growing number of lone mothers and childless workingwomen are testament to this fact. Such women are by definition the determining influence on the class position of their own households.

One suggestion is that the class position of person be determined without reference to the position of one's household. **Social class of a person may be assessed on the basis of one's occupation.** This approach ignores those women who work as housewives and many who are retired people and unemployed.

Lesson 32
EXPLANATIONS OF GENDER INEQUALITY

Each of sociology's major theoretical paradigms addresses the significance of gender in social organization. Functionalist, conflict, inter-actionist, and feminist theories offer alternative explanations for gender inequalities.

Functionalist Explanations

Functionalists view inequality as a product of the traditional division in human societies. **Men tend to attend to more instrumental (objectively rewarded) tasks such as wage earning and women attend to more expressive (subjectively rewarded) tasks such as those involved in child rearing. While both types of labor are functional (indeed vital) for society's survival,** the instrumental tasks, looked after by men, always have been more highly rewarded than the expressive tasks looked after by women. Men and women are taught these traditional roles and have tended to conform to their requirements. Functionalists point out that, while gender roles and their accompanying inequalities have changed somewhat in industrialized societies, traditional arrangement remains in force in most societies. The persistence of the traditional division of labour, according to functionalist view, testifies to the usefulness for human societies.

Conflict Explanations

Conflict theories deny the historically inevitability and necessity of the traditional division of labor between men and women. The arrangement may have been more functional in non-industrialized societies, where physical strength was required by many tasks. However, industrialization has changed the situation. The continuance of the

traditional gendered division of labour and the social inequality that it produces merely contributes to unnecessary social conflict and therefore is dysfunctional.

Capitalism intensifies male domination because:

- Capitalism creates more wealth, which confers greater power on men as owners of property and as primary wage earners.
- An expanding capitalist economy depends on turning people – especially women – into consumers and encouraging them to seek personal fulfillment through buying and using products.
- To support men in the factories, society assigns women the task of maintaining the home.
- The double exploitation of capitalism lies in paying low wages to male labour and no wages at all for female work.

Inter-actionist Explanations

Inter-actionist theories of gender inequality focus on how/omen and men, encouraging violence against women in the form of rape, domestic abuse, sexual harassment, and pornography.

1. **Promoting sexual autonomy.** Feminists advocate women's control of their sexuality and reproduction. Feminists support the free availability of birth control information. Most feminists also support a women's right to choose whether to bear children or terminate pregnancy, rather than allowing men – as husbands, physicians, and legislators – to control women's sexuality. Many feminists support the gay people's efforts to overcome the many barriers they face in a predominantly heterosexual culture.

Opposition to Feminism

Feminism provokes criticism and resistance from both men and women who hold conventional ideas about gender. Some men oppose feminism for the same reasons that may white people have historically opposed

social equality for the people of cooler. **They want to preserve their women privileges.** Other men and women, including those who are neither rich nor powerful, distrust social movement (especially its radical expressions) that attacks the family and rejects time-honoured patterns that have guided male-female relationship for centuries.

For some men, feminism threatens the basis of their status and self-respect: their masculinity Men who have been socialized to value strength and dominance feel uneasy about feminist ideas of men as gentle and warm. Similarly women whose lives center on their husbands and children may see feminism as trying to deprive them their cherished roles that give meaning to their lives.

Resistance to feminism also comes from academic circles. **Some Sociologists charge that feminism willfully ignores a growing body of evidence that men and women do think and act in somewhat different ways (which may make gender equality impossible)**. Also feminism downgrades the crucial and unique contribution women make to the development of children – especially during the first years of life.

Finally, there is the question of *how* women should go about improving their social standing. The idea is that women should have equal rights, but women should advance individually, according to their abilities. Women should expect to get ahead on the basis of their own training and qualifications.

Observations about the likely state of gender

Movement toward gender equality has progressed ahead. Industrialization has both broadened the range of human activity and shifted the nature of work from physically demanding tasks that flavored male strength to jobs that require human thought and imagination,

putting the talents of women and men on equal footing. Additionally, medical technology has given control over reproduction, so women's lives are less constrained by unwanted pregnancies.

Many women and men have also deliberately pursued social equality. Sexual harassment complaints now are taken much more seriously in the workplace. And as more women assume positions of power in the corporate and political worlds, social changes in the 21st century may be as great as those we have already witnessed.

Gender is an important part of personal identity and family life, and it is deeply woven into the moral fabric of the society. Therefore, efforts at change will continue to provoke opposition. On balance, however, while changes may be incremental, the movement toward a society in which men and women enjoy equal rights and opportunities seems certain to gain strength.

LESSON 33

FUNCTIONS OF SCHOOLING

Education is a social institution that is guiding the society's transmission of knowledge – including basic facts, job skills, and also cultural norms and values – to its members. In industrial societies education is largely a matter of schooling, formal instruction under the direction of specially trained teachers.

The extent of schooling in any society is closely tied to its level of economic development. Industrial, high-income societies endorse the idea that everyone should go to school. Schooling in low-income nations is very diverse because it reflects local culture. In low-income countries there is not much of it. **About one half of all elementary age children**

ever get to school, and perhaps only one half of them reach the secondary grades.

Structural-functional analysis looks at how formal education contributes to the operation of society. The important functions performed by schooling are:

Socialization

Technologically simple societies transmit their ways of life informally from parents to children. As societies develop complex technology, kin can no longer stay abreast of rapidly expanding information and skills. Thus schooling gradually emerges as a distinctive social institution employing specially trained personnel to convey the knowledge needed for adult roles**. In primary school children learn basic language and mathematical skills.** Secondary school builds on this foundation, and for many, college allows further specialization. Schools pass on society's core values from one generation to another. Schools are used for the inculcation of its values – values bout work, family, population, democracy, justice, and so on.

Schools explicitly instruct students in our political way of life. It may be called political socialization. **From the earliest grades, rituals such as saluting the flag and singing the national anthem foster patriotism**. Similarly classroom drills develop competitive individualism, respect for authority, and a sense of fair play.

Cultural Innovation

Education creates as well as transmits culture. Schools stimulate intellectual inquiry and critical thinking, sparking the development of new ideas. **At college and university the teachers are busy in research to expand our knowledge in countless areas**. Medical

research conducted at major universities over the years has increased our life expectancy, just as research by sociologists and psychologist helps us to take advantage of our longevity.

Social Change

Not only the schools generate new knowledge, they are also the means for bringing social change. Education may lead to dispelling the traditional attitudes and values. **Education is likely to widen the perspectives of the youth, make them 'rational', willing to accept new ideas and carrying the message forward.**

Social Integration

Schooling helps forge a mass of people into a unified society. This integrative function is especially important in nations with pronounced social diversity, where various cultures know little about – or may even be hostile to – one another. **A basic way schools integrate culturally diverse people is by teaching a common language that encourages broad communication and builds a national identity.**

Social Placement

Schools help in identifying and developing each student's aptitudes and abilities and then evaluating a student's performance in terms of achievement rather than social background. Teachers encourage the "best and the brightest" to pursue the most challenging and advanced studies, while guiding students with more ordinary ability into educational programs suited to their talents**. In this way schooling enhances meritocracy by making personal merit a foundation of future social position.**

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Formal education helps people assume culturally approved statuses and perform roles that contribute to the ongoing life of society. In this way the schools prepare the youth for making a living.

Perpetuating Inequality

Schools provide learning according students' background, thereby perpetuating inequality. **Schools also help continuing inequality between men and women i.e. more boys go to school than girls**; girls select different subjects than boys. Schools reinforce the cultural values of gender inequality.

School Tracking

Schools help the assignment of students to different types of educational programs. This is a usual practice in most of the developed countries. Aptitude tests are given to students at grade 8, and with the help of guidance and counseling, students are put on different streams**. The official justification for tracking is to give students the kind of learning that fits their abilities and motivation.**

Research shows that social background has as much to do with tracking as personal aptitudes. Students from affluent families generally do well on standardized "scientific" tests and are to better tracks while those with modest backgrounds end up in programs that curb their aspirations and teach technical trades. Tracking effectively segregates students – academically and socially – into different worlds.

Qualification Certification

Schools not only transmit the knowledge and skills to the youth, they are also the agencies that certify the level of education achieved.

Other Latent Functions

Schools perform many latent functions. Schools have become vital for relieving single and dual earner parents of some childcare responsibilities. Schools help in establishing social networks School help stabilize employment. Schools continue to hold on to the youth for a longer period – a period, which be utilized for the creation of job opportunities for the educated youth.

Lesson 34
ISSUES IN EDUCATION

Background

Pakistan has yet to cover a long way on the road to one hundred percent literacy of its population. From around 40 percent literacy in 1998 it has moved to an estimated 54 percent in 2004. There are gaps between the literacy levels of males and females as well as between rural and urban populations. The Government of Pakistan is pursuing the policy of Education for All (EFA) and expects that by 2015 all children will complete primary education. Another claim is to eliminate gender disparity in education by 2005. These may be tall claims but not something, which is unachievable. Despite the Government efforts to increase the number of Primary schools, the number of teachers, and the school enrollment, the absolute number of non-literates is swelling. It has increased from 22 million in 1961 to 69 million in 2004. The private -sector, public-private partnerships, and the nongovernmental organizations are making their efforts to combat illiteracy but the achievements are clouded by a variety of factors like the increasing population, the availability of resources, and the politics of education. In the pursuit of the policy of Education for All there are a number of issues that have to be considered.

Issues

Low Enrollment

It is estimated that out of the total school-going age children around 50 percent are not in school.
There could be number of reasons for children not being in school. Poverty may be one of the most important reasons. Primary schooling may be free, still there are many other indirect costs related to sending the child to school – uniform, stationery, food, contributions to some other school funds, etc. But of all these costs, the most important cost appears to be the "opportunity cost" that the parents have to forego for sending their child to school. The child might be working or could work at some place and could bring some income to the family. By sending the child to school the parents shall have to forego that income, which may be necessary for their survival. This is a big issue and the parents have strong rationale for it.

High Dropout

Of the children entering the school at grade one, 50 percent of them dropout prior to their completion of primary stage of schooling. There could be number of reasons – no fun at school, no class stimulation, corporal punishment, teacher discrimination, poor health, lack of schooling's vocational usefulness, parental demand for child's employment. Many of these factors appear to be relevant to the school environment, which seem to be devoid of any attraction for the child from the lower class. Consequently, there is high dropout rate of children.

Gender Disparity

Gender disparity in the estimated literacy rates shows that of males 66 percent were literate whereas of females 42 percent were literate in 2004. This disparity is expected to be wider in the rural areas. One of the reasons could be the lack of facilities for the female education and other, perhaps the most important, discouraging societal attitude towards the schooling of girls.

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Inequalities in Education

Inequalities can be looked at from different angles – gender inequalities, rural-urban inequalities, public-private school inequalities, and inequality due to the medium of instruction. This is where the followers of conflict school of thought are very critical of the inequalities built into the structure of the society, which are recreated, reinforced, and perpetuated by the schooling system.

Low budgetary Allocations

Educational institutions are often under resourced which may be reflective of the priority being given to education thereby low financial allocations. Even the use of whatever is allocated has administrative difficulties. Delayed release of funds, and misuse of funds (ghost schools) have negative impact on the quantity as well as quality of schooling. Within the education sector, higher education levels at college and university get bigger chunk of budget than at the lower level. Poor section of the population is expected to be minimal at the higher level, which implies that the system is supportive of the 'better of', thereby perpetuating the inequalities.

Standard of Pedagogy

Quality of teaching depends upon the quality of teachers. In Pakistani schools, at the foundation level the teachers have been having very low qualifications, and, in turn are also low paid. The focus has been more on rote learning rather than on the development of the whole child. The authoritarian approach has been often accompanied by corporal punishment, which terrorizes the students, particularly from the poor families, and drives them away. Recently there has been some policy change with the up gradation of the qualifications of Primacy School Teacher, which may have some positive impacts on the classroom environment.

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Poor School Environment

A substantial number of schools have been found to be poorly organized and devoid of facilities.
Facilities may refer to the availability of the teachers as well as the infrastructure facilities reflecting the level of school enrichment. At places schools are without an appropriate building [A government survey's revelation that 14000 schools in Sindh did not have any building. Eighty percent had no electricity, 60 percent had no boundary wall or drinking water facility, and 57 percent had no toilets.
The necessary classroom equipment. The students have to beat the severities of weather with the only choice of dropping out of the school, and that is not a good choice. Although the local community may partly contribute in improving the physical facilities, but the ultimate responsibility, particularly with respect to the provision of staff, rests with the government.

Quality of Textbooks

Provision of education is one thing and what are the contents of education being provided is another. At the school level all books being taught are prescribed by the government and produced by the Provincial Textbook Boards. What is being imparted through these books and what is their quality are the issues to be discussed. A recent evaluation of the textbooks by Sustainable Development and Policy Institute generated a lot of debate about the kind of indoctrination we want to live with. On the whole the books appear to be least child friendly.

Quality of Curricula

In order to meet the changing demands of time the curricula has to be continuously updated. Since the experts are often critical of the out-dated curricula being followed in our system of education, therefore it needs attention.

Examination System

The examination system is fast losing it credibility.

Lesson 35

POPULATION STUDY AND ITS SIGNIFICANCE

Demography is the statistical description and analysis of human population. It refers to ascertaining the numbers and distribution of people, changes in the numbers and distribution of people over time, age and sex composition, birth and death rates among various quantities of populations.

Study of population seeks to discover the causes and consequences of population changes. The changes in population take place primarily due to changes in births, deaths and migration, which are referred to as the three components of population change.

- The number of total persons which is usually referred to as size
- The characteristics of population, called composition
- Where are these people located, labeled as distribution of population.

Prior to the discussion of the significance of the study of population it seems pertinent to explain some of the basic concepts likely to be used in this discourse.

BASIC CONCEPTS

Crude Birth Rate: The number of live births per year per thousand of the population.

$$\frac{\text{Total births in a specific year}}{\text{----------}} \times 1000$$

Total population in that year

The CBR is “crude” because

(1) It does not take into account, which people in the population were actually can produce a child

(2) It ignores the age structure of the population. Crude birth rates are very general statistics that are useful for making overall comparisons between different groups, societies and regions.

Fertility: The number of live-born children the average woman has. It may be called child women ratio.

Total No. of children aged 0-4 in year X

Total No. of women aged 15-49 in year X

A fertility rate is usually calculated as the average number of births per thousand women of childbearing age (15-49 years).

Total births in year X

---------- X 1000

Total women aged 15-49

Fecundity: The potential number of children a normal woman is biologically capable of bearing. It is physically possible for a normal woman to bear a child every year during part of her life when she is capable of conception. While there may be families in which a woman bears twenty or more children, fertility rate are always much lower than fecundity rates because social and cultural factors limit breeding.

Crude Death Rate: The number of deaths per thousand of the population per year.

$$\frac{\text{Total death in a specific year}}{\text{Total population in that year}} \times 1000$$

Crude death rates are also called as mortality rates.

Mortality: The number of deaths in a population.

Infant Mortality Rate: The number of babies per thousand live births in any year who die before reaching the age of one year.

Life Expectancy: The number of years an average person can expect to live. Life expectancy has increased in most societies in the world in the past century.

Life Span: The maximum number of years that an individual could live.

Migration: The Permanent movement of persons over a significant distance.

International migration: Migrant crosses the boundary between one country and another. Emigrant: When persons leave their country. Immigrant: When persons arrive in another country.

Internal migration: Migration within a country.

Population Census: The simultaneous recording of demographic data by government, at a particular time, pertaining to all persons who live in a particular territory. It usually takes place after every 10 years.

Vital Statistics: Registration of a person's birth, changes in civil status throughout his/her lifetime, and his/her death.

SIGNIFICANCE OF POPULATIONS STUDY

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There are three main questions to look into the significance of population study:

1. **How many people?** It refers to the size of the population in a territory. While looking at the size, one also looks at the changes that are taking place in the size. How are these changes being effected by the trends in birth rate, death rate, and in migration?
2. **What kind of people?** It refers to the composition of the population. The composition includes the characteristics of the population with respect to the age structure, sex differences, literacy rate and levels of literacy, religious distribution, languages people speak, occupational structure, housing structure, etc. In addition to the absolute figures showing the characteristics one also looks at the changes that might be taking place in the composition of the population as well as its future implications.
3. **How are people distributed in the area**? Distribution of population refers to the dispersion of people in a territory like the rural-urban distribution, size of cities, densities of population. Analysis of the distribution takes into account the prospective changes as well as its future effects.

People belonging to different walks of life are interested in the existing as well as the foreseeable trends in the size, composition and distribution of population. For example a planner is looking at the size of the population because he has to tie it with other social and economic resources of the country. He has to look into the correlations between the size of population and the economic development of the country. How are the changes in population size influencing the economic development and vice a versa? The composition of the population may be reflective of quality of the human resource, which can be utilized for the development of the economy. The changes in the composition may

also suggest the kind of investments needed in the various components of the population. The distribution of population is of specific interest to the planner when he has to look into the varying needs of people at different places.

From the political perspective one has to look into the size of population while determining the boundaries of constituent areas as well as the number of members of the National Assembly, the Senate, and Provincial Assemblies. The information about the composition as well as the distribution of population helps in the determining the number of voters, the type of voters, and the location of voters.

A businessman shall be interested in the population because he uses the manpower in the production of goods and services and ultimately he shall be looking for the consumers of his goods and services. At various stage of his business operations he shall be interested in all the three components of population i.e., size, composition, and distribution. He produces goods and services keeping in view the characteristics of the ultimate consumers. The study of population is of utmost significance to an educationist because he has to look into the educational needs of the population and arrange the facilities accordingly. What is the size of population, of which how many are of school going age, what is the their gender, what is the occupational background of their parents, where are they located - in rural/urban areas, are some of the pertinent questions about which he should have enough information prior to chalking out an action program. The study of population helps in providing the relevant information.

These examples suggest that in whatever field we work, the demographic information is of utmost value for planning, implementation, and success of any plan. The causes and consequences of changes in the size, composition, and distribution of population have

a bearing on the socio-economic development of the country.

Lesson 36

THEORY OF POPULATION GROWTH

In pre-modern societies, birth rates were very high by the standards of industrialized world today. Nonetheless, population growth quite was low until the 18th century because there was a rough overall balance between births and deaths. The general trend of the numbers was upwards, and there were sometimes periods of more marked population increase, but these were followed by increase in death rates. During the period of the rise industrialism, many looked forward to a new age in which scarcity would be a phenomenon of the past. The development of modern industry, it was widely supposed, would create a new era of abundance in which standards of living would rise. **These ideas were criticized by Thomas Robert Malthus (1766-1834), a clergyman and an economist**.

Malthusian Theory of Population

In 1798 Malthus published an Essay on the Principle of Population. By analyzing the then prevailing situation in different countries Malthus initiated a debate about the connection between population and food resources that continues to this day. His premise was that:

(1) Food was necessary for the continuation of life,
(2) Procreation was also necessary for the continuation of life.

Necessity of food for human survival is to continue, similarly the passions between the sexes are to continue, and both are natural necessities of life. But the two necessary factors of human life grow at different rate. Whereas population size increases geometrically (2, 4, 8, 16, 32, 64), the food supply increases arithmetically (1, 2, 3, 4, 5, 6,).

Population size, therefore, always pushes against the limits of food supply needed to support the population. There is a limit to increase the food supply by bringing more land under cultivation but there is limit to that. With the existing rate of growth, the population was expected to double every 25 years. For such a high growth rate of population, human beings should adopt such measures to check the growth of population. In his opinion the population checks were:

a. Preventive checks.
b. Positive checks.

Among the preventive checks, Malthus recommended

(1) To follow celibacy (not marry at all)
(2) To marry late,
(3) Abstinence from entering into sexual unions resulting in procreation. If human beings don't adopt the "preventive checks", "positive checks" come into operation in the form of famine, epidemics, war, and other natural calamities, and a lot of population is wiped out. For the remaining population food supply may be sufficient, though it may be a temporary relief.

Positive checks are the things which occur when sarcastic occurs. These are as follow

(1) Famine
(2) War
(3) Epidemics
(4) Natural calamities

There has been lot of **criticism of Malthusian theory** of population by arguing that:

1. Malthus **did not visualize the power of science and technology with the help of which the food supply could be revolutionized.** Even one country like Canada could produce so much of wheat that could be sufficient for the whole of the world. But will Canada supply wheat free? Not at all. Even if it is free some countries may not even have the ability to bear the transportation costs.
2. Malthus did not **advocate the use of contraceptives as a means of preventive measure**, though these were available during his times. Being a clergyman perhaps he did not consider the advocacy of the use of contraceptives as appropriate.

Malthus presented a too pessimistic picture of the growth of population. Population of many technologically advanced countries did not follow his predictions. Nevertheless, the essay on population growth by Malthus generated lot of discussion on the topic, **and Malthus may rightly be considered as the father of population studies.** The more guarded outlook is that we no longer could use technology as an excuse to ignore Malthus.

Theory of Demographic Transition

Demographic transition theory links birth rates and death rates to a society's level of industrialization – the process by which a society's economy shifts from a predominantly agricultural and handicraft base to a predominantly industrial and large scale manufacturing base. There are four stages in the demographic transition as seen in the figure.

(1) Stage 1

During the **pre-industrial stage**, **high birth rates are balanced by high death rates,** and population size remains fairly stable.

Today the least industrialized nations of the world are in this **demographic stage**.

(2) Stage 2

The **stage of increasing industrialization**, the death rate falls primarily because of the improved sanitation, hygiene, and medical conditions. The birth rate, however, remains high because of the continued influence of traditional values favoring large families. Having several children ensures survival of at least some of them when infant mortality is high. **During this stage the imbalance between the falling death rate and the high birth rate results in high population growth.** Pakistan like many other developing nations is in this stage of transition.

(3) Stage 3

The **third stage the traditional values** give way to modern values favoring contraception and family planning. Birth rates decline as a result of later ages at marriage, urbanization, industrialization, rising aspirations, and other factors. The mortality rates eventually stabilize at low level and birth rates follow. The shift from high to low mortality and fertility is known as the **"demographic transition**". This shift occurred throughout Europe, North America, and a number of other areas in the 19th and early 20th centuries, and started in many developing countries in the middle of 20th century. Although the pace and paths of decline varied tremendously among countries, the demographic transition emerged as the dominant model of demographic change.

(4) Stage 4

At the fourth stage the birth rates fall to about the same level as mortality rates. With births and deaths at similar low levels, the equilibrium of slow population growth is regained.

The pace of change in a country varies depending on its culture, level of economic development, and other factors. As countries pass through the various stages of the transition, population growth from natural increase (birth rate - death rate) accelerates or decelerates depending upon the gap between birth rate and the death rate. **Many developing countries are in an intermediate stage, in which mortality and fertility are falling at varying rates but are still high relative to the levels of Europe and other more developed areas**. Many low-fertility countries have entered what some describe as a "second demographic transition" in which fertility falls below the two-child replacement level as forces of contemporary life interfere with childbearing. This transition has been linked with greater educational and job opportunities for women, the availability of effective contraception, a shift away from formal marriage, the acceptance of childbearing outside marriage, and the rise of individualism and materialism. Experts disagree about whether all countries will follow the transition experienced in Europe and about whether there are additional stages of transition that we have not identified – long-term population decline, for example. But the demographic transition theory provides a useful framework for assessing demographic trends and projecting future population size.

Lesson 37

POPULATION PROFILE OF PAKISTAN

How does population grow?

Prior to the discussion of the population profile of Pakistan let us see how does population grow? If we are looking at the world population growth then it is simply:
Births – Deaths in a year per1000 population. Suppose births in a year are 40 and deaths are 10 then 40 – 10 = 30 per 1000 population or 3.0 per cent growth rate per annum. (Population growth rate is presented in percentages).

For a country population growth rate is calculated as: Births – Deaths + (immigration – emigration).

For a province or district population growth within a country: Births – Deaths + (immigration – emigration) + (In-migration – Out-migration). In-migration and out-migration is the internal migration within the country.

Urban area population growth within a country: Births – Deaths + (immigration –emigration) + (In- migration – Out-migration) + Expansion in the urban area.

Suppose the population grows at 3 percent per annum, what does it mean?

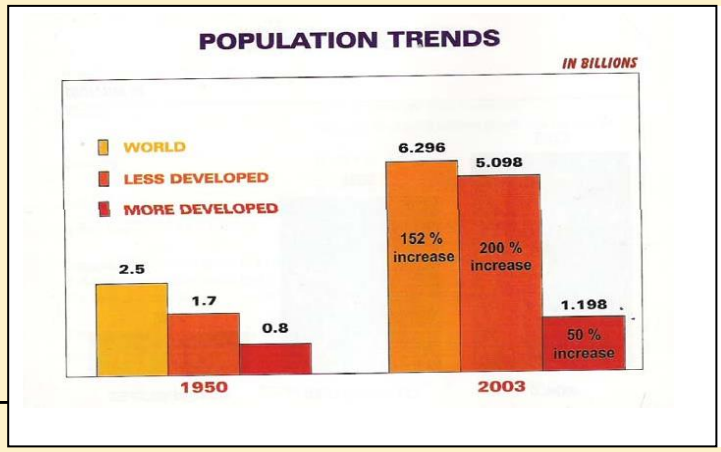
It means the population would double in 23 years. How? The formula is very simple: Just divide 70 years by the rate of growth: 70/3 = 23 years.
It may be called **LAW OF**

SEVENTY. **World Population**

Growth

Population growth trends show that the world population in 1950 was 2.5 billion which increased to
6.296 billion in 2003, showing 152 percent increase (see fig. 1). In the less developed countries, during the same period, the population increased from 1.7 billion to 5.098 billion, showing an increase of 200 percent. Compared with them in the more developed countries, during the same period, the population increased from 0.8 billion to 1.198 billion, indicating only a 50 percent increase. These figures suggest that the world population is increasing very fast; and the biggest contribution to this increase is being made by the less developed

countries.



9

Population has been growing slowly in the past. It took thousands of years for the world population to reach the figure of 1 billion, which was estimated to be in the year1804 (see table 1). It took only 123 year to add the second billion to the population of this planet and that happened in 1927. For the addition of third billion it took only 33 years and that happened in 1960. The population of the world has been growing so fast that for the addition of fourth billion it took only 13 years which was in 1974. For the addition of fifth billion it took only 12 years and that was in 1987. Within the next 12 years the world population has seen the addition of sixth billion, which happened in 1999. Presently we have more than 6 billion people living on this planet earth and the population is still growing.

Table 1: Time taken to add one billion to world population

Year	World Population	Years
1804	1	---
1927	2	123
1960	3	33
1974	4	14
1987	5	13
1999	6	12

In table 2 it is interesting to note that the more developed regions have less population (1198 million in 2003) and high GNP/capita ($ 22060 in 2002) compared with less developed regions (population 5098 million and GNP/capita of $3580).

Table 2: Population and GNP/capita

Region	Population (million) 2003	GNP/ Capita ($) 2000
World	6296	7140
More Dev	1198	22060
Less Dev	5098	3580

Specifically talking about Pakistan, table 3 shows that the country has an area of 0.796 million sq. kilometers which comes to be 0.6 percent of the world. With respect to population it had reached an estimated 151 million people in 2004 which was 2.4 percent of the world population.

Table 3: Pakistan: Share of the World 2004

Area	0.796 Million Sq. Km.	0.6 %
Population	151 Million	2.4 %

Information provided in table 4 shows that in 2003 the world population was growing at the rate of 1.3 percent and it was expected that it will take 54 years to double it population. Since the more developed regions of the world have been growing at the rate of only 0.1 percent therefore it will take a very long

period (700 years) to double its population. Compared with them the less developed regions have been growing at the rate of 1.6 percent, therefore they will take comparatively shorter time to double their population (44 years).

In 2003 Pakistan had a population of 148.6 million, which was growing at the rate of 2.06 percent, and it was estimated that its population will double in 34 years. Compared with other countries in the region like Bangladesh, Iran, India, and Indonesia, Pakistan has higher rate of population growth, therefore it is likely to take shorter period to double than the said countries.

Table 4: Population, rate of growth and doubling time, 2003

Regions	Population (Million)	Growth Rate (%)	Doubling Time (years.)
World	6296	1.3	54
More Developed	1198	0.1	700
Less Developed	5098	1.6	44
Pakistan	148.6	2.06	34
Bangladesh	136	1.7	41
Iran	66	1.2	58
India	1067	1.7	41
Indonesia	220	1.6	44

The population of the country is increasing quite rapidly. Table 5 shows that in 1950 Pakistan with 33 million people was at 14th place in population rank order of the countries. In 2004 with 151 million people, by surpassing China, India, USA, Indonesia, and Brazil, Pakistan was at 6th place in population rank order of the countries. During the last 54 years the population of the country has increased about five times.

Table 5: Pakistan's population rank order in the world

Year	Rank	Population (Million)
1950	14	33
2004	6*	151

*** After China, India, USA, Indonesia, and Brazil having surpassed Japan, Bangladesh, Nigeria, Russia, etc.**

Prior to 1961-71 decade the rate of growth has been lower than what has been found in 2004. One of the important reasons was the high death rate which had been neutralizing the high birth rate. In line with the theory of demographic transition the death rate falls earlier than a decline in the birth rate and also the death rate declines sharply thereby creating a big gap between the birth rate and the death rate resulting in relatively high growth rate. Pakistan has been certainly passing through demographic transition as one can see a rise in population growth during the census period of 1961- 72 (3.66), then tapering of during 1972-81(3.05), and then further decline (2.69) during 1981-1998 as well as during 2003-04 (1.9) (see table 6).

Table 6: Population growth rate in Pakistan

Period	Growth Rate (%)
1951-61	2.45
1961-71	3.66
1972-81	3.05
1981-98	2.69
2003-04	1.90

Although there is some visible declining trend in the population growth rate, yet the mere fact that the number of persons being added annually is so huge that the overall impact may not be remarkable.

One could look at the number of births that took place during the year 2002. The data presented in table 7 show that in one year 4, 366, 270 births took place which comes to as 8 births per minute being added to the population of the country.

Table 7: Number of births, deaths, and net addition of population during 2002

Time period	No. of births	No. of deaths	Net addition
In One Year	4,366,270	1,222,000	3,144,270
Per Month	363,855	101,833	262, 022
Per Day	11,962	3,348	8,614
Per Minute	8	2	6 .

Looking at the number of deaths, there were 1,222,000 cases in the year 2002, which comes to 2 deaths per minute. The resultant difference between births and deaths shows that every minute 6 persons and by the year 3,144,270 persons were being added to the population of Pakistan. The addition of 3.14 million persons means adding the population equal to the cities of Multan + Sukkar + Peshawar + Quetta. For these people the government may have to arrange facilities for their decent standard of living.

MUHAMMAD HAMZA KHALIL

Lesson 38

POPULATION PROFILE OF PAKISTAN (Continued)

Composition

In lecture 37 we looked at the size of population. Lecture 38 shall focus on the composition of population of Pakistan as well as some implications of the Population Planning Program. In the composition of population first of let us look at the age distribution of the people of Pakistan.

Age Distribution

According to 1998 Population Census of Pakistan, 43 percent of the population was of children under 15 years, 53 percent was between the ages of 15-64 years, and about 4 percent was 65 years and over This information shows that a big proportion of the population has been of children implying that they are dependents on the economy of the country. About four percent of the population happens to be of old persons, another group of dependents. About one half of the population is that of women, who, with the exception of few, are usually considered as dependents. In this way the age structure of the population of Pakistan shows that majority (nearly two thirds) of them are dependents. Of the dependents, children need special services like health, education, playground, and family care. In this way the young population puts special demand on the resources of the country. Similarly the senior citizens need special services.

Sex Composition

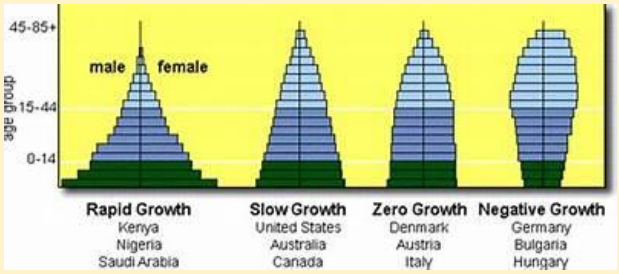
According to 1998 Population Census sex composition of the population shows that 52 percent of the total was that of males and 48 percent was of females out of which 22% female are in reproductive age This

information shows that there is high sex ratio which means that the number of males per 100 females is much higher than 100 females. This is typical of developing countries which, among other factors, may be reflective of the status of women. In most of the developed countries the situation is quite the opposite indicating a greater proportion of women than men in the population.

Age and Sex Pyramid

Age and sex distribution of the population of Pakistan gives us a specific type of pyramid which is typical of developing countries (see fig 3). This pyramid has a very broad base indicating a large number of children (43%). In this pyramid one could also see that at the lower ages (0-4) that there does not seem to be much difference between the number of males and females. As we move up the pyramid the number of females starts declining due to various reasons like the neglect of female children, poor

Prior to the industrial revolution the age and sex pyramids of the developed countries also looked like those of the present day developing countries. Just by looking at the population pyramid one could easily tell whether this pyramid is that of a highly developed country, a developed country, or that of a developing country (see fig. 4). As one can see from the figure, the base of the population pyramid of a developing country is very broad indicating that the population has a large number of children. The population of such countries has the potential of rapid growth. Sex ratio is in favor of males. Then there is a sharp tapering off of the pyramid whereby it becomes conical. At the senior citizen's age the proportion of population is very small.



As the countries move on the scale of development, its birth rates start falling and the base of the pyramid does not remain broad and also it does not remain as steep as it was seen in case of developing countries. The bars indicating the male and female distribution start becoming different. The bars indicating the females start becoming longer than those of bars for males. Since the pyramid is no more conical, therefore it indicates that the proportion of old persons in the population starts increasing. On the whole the population of such countries shows slow growth rate.

Countries with zero population growth have a barrel shaped pyramid. Here different bars representing age become almost equal except at the top for the senior citizen. The bars at each age for females are either equal to the bars for males or these are longer than the bars for males.

There is also a pyramid showing "negative growth" of population. In this pyramid the base of the pyramid is quite squeezed indicating that there are no children. This pyramid starts bulging out from the middle suggesting some increase in adult population which is primarily due to immigrants entering the country to fill the gap created by the declining fertility of the local population. This pyramid has become comparatively broad at the top due to the increase in the number of old people. Countries with such population have "aging" population.

Literacy Composition

MUHAMMAD HAMZA KHALIL

Literacy has been considered to be a crucial variable in the development of a country. Pakistan started with a very low literacy rate. In 1961 only 17 percent of the population aged 10 year and above was literate. There have been small increases in the literacy rates in the country. Table 1 shows that at the time of third population census (1972) there was small increase of 5 percentage points over the previous population census of 1961 and an increase of small percentage points have been observed at the time of every population census. During the year 2004 literacy rate in the country has been estimated to be at 54 percent.

Table 1: Literacy rate (%)

year	Literacy rate (%)	Illiteracy rate(millions)
1961	17	22
1972	22	33
1981	26	42
1990	35	35
1998	40	40
2004	54	54

Distribution of Population in 1998

67%rural

33% urban

Implications of Population Program

Given the scenario of population growth in the country, the government of Pakistan started population program about fifty years back. Over the years a good amount of effort has gone into it for the creation of

awareness about family planning, changing the attitudes of couples in its favor, and motivating the couples for the adoption of family planning practices (the use of contraceptives). As an outcome of government investments as well as through the efforts of NGOs some of the parameters of population are given in table 3. The data show that there has been progress on three important parameters of knowledge about family planning, the use of contraceptives, and fertility rate. It has been found that as of 2004 there were 96 percent couples who were in the know-of family planning but only a little over one third were using some family planning method (contraceptive). There appears to be a big gap between the knowledge about family planning and the practicing of family planning. It has been found that the fertility rate (the total number of children born to a woman during her life time) has declined for example from 5.4 children per woman in 1991, to 4.9 in 1997, to 4.1 children in 2004.

Table 3: Population parameters (1991 to 2004)

Parameter	1991	1997	2004
Knowledge (%)	78	94	96
Use of Contraceptives	12	24	34
Fertility rate	5.4	4.9	4.1

Looking at the world situation, the information provided in table 4 shows that the population growth rate (PGR) of the world in 2002 was 1.3 percent, and the contraceptive prevalence rate (CPR) of 61 percent. In the more developed regions of the world the PGR was 0.1 and CPR 68 percent whereas in the less developed regions the corresponding PGR was 1.6 and CPR was 60 percent. Asian figures show a PGR of 1.3 percent and CPR of 64. Comparing with this situation it looks that Pakistan has yet to cover long distance to come closer to the average figures of Asia or of less developed regions, what to think about the figures of more developed regions.

Table 4: Population Growth Rate (PGR) and Contraceptive Prevalence Rate (CPR) 2002

Regions	PGR (%)	CPR (%)
World	1.3	61
Developed	0.1	68
Developing	1.6	60
Asia	1.3	64

Comparing Pakistan with some of the Muslim countries, the information provided in table 5 shows that Pakistan is way behind Iran, Turkey, Morocco, Indonesia, Egypt and Bangladesh on the counts of CPR, PGR, and TFR. A program which is well accepted in some other Muslim countries, why it is not that much accepted in Pakistan? We have to explore the reasons for such differences.

Table 5: PGR, CPR, and Total Fertility Rate (TFR), 2002

Muslim	TFR	PGR	CPR

countries			
Egypt	3.5	2.0	56
Morocco	3.1	1.9	58
Turkey	2.5	1.5	64
Iran	2.5	1.2	74
Indonesia	2.6	1.6	57
Bangladesh	3.3	1.7	55
Pakistan	4.1	1.9	37

LESSON 40
POPULATION POLICY

MUHAMMAD HAMZA KHALIL

A **policy** is a formalized set of procedures to guide behavior. The purpose of policy could be either to alter or maintain consistency of behavior to achieve a specific goal.
Population policy is a strategy for achieving a particular pattern of population change. Population policy may be single purpose like reducing crude birth rate by 20 per 1000 or it could be multifaceted like rationalizing the reproductive behavior. For population policy it is necessary to assess the future population trends and its implications.

Future oriented people need policy. Population policies may be for retarding growth, or promoting growth or it could be for maintaining population growth. No country can ignore the issue of population policy. An important question is: Is present population explosion in Pakistan the result of high fertility?
How about the rapidly declining death rate and increasing life expectancy? There in fact is "the man's triumph over death." We do find that the total fertility rate (TFR) has fallen the world wide which is 3.6. In the developing countries it has come down to 4.1 children per woman. Nevertheless, Pakistan is still passing through the demographic transition where the birth rate has lagged behind the declining death rate. This cultural lag has already resulted in population explosion. In Pakistan the TFR has come down to 4.1 which is still very high. The fertility rate that produces stabilization of population is the replacement level which is 2.1 births per woman. The TFR in Pakistan is twice high than the replacement level.
Given the structure of population in Pakistan it may be pointed out that even if we reach the replacement level population growth will continue. The important reason being the young population age structure of Pakistan. This is usually referred to as *population momentum* which means the tendency of the population size to increase for some time even after a two child family average is reached. Since record number of young people are entering the childbearing ages therefore the population may continue to grow for three more decades even after the acceptance of two child family norms, which is a replacement level.

MUHAMMAD HAMZA KHALIL

Vision of Population Policy

The government of Pakistan launched its latest population policy in July 2002. The overall vision of the population policy is to achieve population stabilization by 2020 through the expeditious completion of the demographic transition leading to declines both in fertility and mortality rates.

Goals of Population Policy

The population policy seeks to:

1. Attain a balance between resources and population within the broad parameters of the ICPD paradigm. (ICPD is the international conference on population and development, which was held in Cairo in 1994. In this conference a good number of NGOs participated. It was decided that in future there shall be more emphasis on reproductive health. Family planning shall be part of reproductive health. There was lot of emphasis on women rights).
2. Address various dimensions of population issue within national laws, development priorities while remaining within our national social and cultural norms.
3. Increase awareness of the adverse consequences of rapid population growth both at the national, provincial, district and community level.
4. Provide family planning as an entitlement based on informed and voluntary choice.
5. Attain a reduction in fertility through improvement in access and quality of reproductive health services.
6. Reduce population momentum through a delay in the first birth, changing spacing patterns and reduction in family size desires

Objectives

1. Short Term

a) Reduce population growth to 1.9 percent per annum by 2004. (Government of Pakistan claims that this objective has been achieved).

b) Reduce fertility through enhanced voluntary contraception to 4 births per woman by the year 2004. (Government of Pakistan claims that this objective has been achieved)

2. Long Term

a. Reduce population growth rate from 1.9 percent per annum in 2004 to 1.3 percent per annum by the year 2020.
b. Reduce fertility through enhanced voluntary contraceptive adoption to replacement level of 2.1 births per woman by 2020.
c. Universal access to safe family planning methods by 2010.

Strategies

1. Develop and launch advocacy campaigns to address special groups, such as, policy makers, opinion leaders, youth and adolescents.
2. Promote the small family norm through innovative incentive schemes for users, clients, parents, service providers and program managers.
3. Increase ownership of population issues by the stakeholders and strengthen their participation in the processes of service delivery and program design.
4. Reduce unmet need for family planning services by making available quality family planning family planning and reproductive health services to all married couples who want to limit or space their children.
5. Ensure the provision of quality services especially to the poor, under-served populations in the rural areas and urban slums.
6. Coordinate and monitor a comprehensive network of family planning and reproductive health services in Pakistan.
7. Build strong partnership with concerned line Ministries, Provincial line Departments, Non-Governmental Organizations and the private sector, including industrial sector to maintain standards in family planning by providing assistance/guidance through advocacy, training, monitoring and other means of participation and quality assurance.

8. Strengthen contribution to population activities by civil society players, particularly NGOs and media.
9. Ensure population and family life education for school and college students.

LESSON 41

ENVIRONMENT AND SOCIETY

Environment: Stems from the French world viron, meaning a circle, a round, or the country around. Hence environment means the external conditions and influences affecting the life of an organism, or entire societies, or the "physical and biotic infrastructure" supporting populations of all kind. In this way environment is the total physical and material bases of all life, including land, air, water, and the vital material resources and energy in which societies are embedded. It may be called natural environment.

Natural environment: The earth's surface and atmosphere, including living organisms, air, water, soil, and other resources necessary to sustain life.

Environment serves three distinct functions for societies:

- Provides our home, or the space in which we conduct our activities (living space);
- Supplies us with the resources that are necessary for living (supply depot); and
- Acts as a 'sink' for absorbing the waste products of modern industrial societies (waste repository).

These three functions may compete with each other. Because of increase in population and the related activities:

- There is substantially more conflict between the three functions,
- The total human demand or 'load' may be exceeding the long-term carrying capacity of both specific areas and even of the global ecosystem.

Ecology: The study of interaction of living organisms and the natural environment. Like any other species, humans depend on the natural environment. But it is the humans who have the culture. With the development of culture human beings transform the environment, for better or worse. Where human beings have put nature to its service, the whole process has germinated problems of solid waste, pollution, global warming, biodiversity, etc.

Global Dimension:

Planet is a single eco-system. Echo is 'house', which reminds us that this planet is our home and that all living things and their natural environment are interrelated. It is a system composed of the interaction of all living organisms and their natural environment. Such inter-connectedness means that changes in any part of the natural environment ripple through the entire global ecosystem. For example, ozone is a layer in the atmosphere that restricts the entry of harmful ultraviolet radiation. As a result of environmental changes it is in the depletion process.

Historical Dimension:

How have people gained the power to threaten the natural environment? Human beings have the capacity to develop culture. Continuously the technology is being improved. Human beings have moved from hunting societies to pastorals, to agriculturists, to

industrial society and to post-industrial society. In this process of development it has been seen that humans consume natural resources and release pollutants. Can we say that man has been bending nature? In this process the role of rich countries has been crucial. They produce 1000 times more goods than the poor nations. Raise the standard of living and produce more solid waste and pollution. Where there are material benefits of technology → there are negative effects on the environment like:

Running an environmental deficit:

A profound and negative long-term harm to the natural environment caused by humanity's focus on short-term material affluence. The concept of environmental deficit is important for three reasons.

- First, it reminds us that the state of environment is social issue, reflecting the choices people make about how to live.
- Second, it suggests that environmental damage – to their air, land, or water – is often unintended. By focusing on the short-term benefits of, say cutting down forests, using throwaway packaging, we fail to see their long-term environmental effects.
- Third, in some respects, the environmental deficit is reversible. Inasmuch as societies have created environmental problems, in other words, societies can undo many of them.

Population Increase:

After technology, the rapid growth of population is another threat to the environment. With the economic development the previous balance between the high birth rate and high death rate has been disturbed by the rapid decline in the death rate and the birth rate

lagging behind in its slow decline. The resultant demographic transition has lead to population explosion. By the end of 20th century the planet earth was carrying more than six billion people, out of which about five billion were in the relatively poor countries. Poor people have no choice but to consume whatever is available in the environment.

Cultural Patterns: Growth and Limits

Our cultural outlook is our vision of the good life. It has environmental consequences. People look for material comfort whereby progress and science become the cherished values. Logic of growth is the additional consumption of environment. Nevertheless, the finite resources put limits to growth. Humanity must implement policies to control the growth of population, production, and the use of resources in order to avoid environmental collapse.

MUHAMMAD HAMZA KHALIL

LESSON 42

ENVIRONMENTAL ISSUES

Technological developments, population growth, and cultural outlook have put increasing demands on the natural environment, and people are becoming concerned. People in the third world countries face grave problems of overpopulation and poverty. What are some of the key environmental issues?

Solid Waste: The "Disposable Society"

Think about a day in your life and collect everything that you throw away. How much will it weigh? In an industrial society like US an average person discards about 2.5 kilograms of paper, metal, plastic, and other disposable material daily (over a lifetime about 50 tons). This is the example of a disposable society, where convenience has become a cultural value. A rich society consumes much more and most of the items have throwaway packaging. The most familiar case is that of fast food, served in cardboard, plastic, and Styrofoam containers that we throw away within minutes. Countless other products are elaborately packaged to make the product more attractive to the consumer. The other disposables: the bottles, pens, razors, flashlights, batteries, and other items designed to have limited life. We are fast emulating the cultural patterns of Western society.

Where does this waste go? Since most of it is not recycled, so it never 'goes away'. It needs landfills and poses several threats to the natural environment. So it needs land for disposal, which contributes to water pollution (both above and below the ground). For the protection of environment, this waste has to be recycled.

MUHAMMAD HAMZA KHALIL

Preserving Clean Water

Oceans, lakes, and streams supply the lifeblood of the global ecosystem. Humans depend on water for drinking, bathing, cooling, cooking, recreation, agriculture, and host of other activities. According to what scientists call the hydrological cycle, the earth naturally recycles water and refreshes the land. The process begins as heat from the sun causes the earth's water to evaporate and form clouds. Water then returns to earth as rain, which drains into streams and rivers and rushes towards sea. This hydrological cycle not only renews the supply of water but cleans it as well. Pollutants steadily build up that affect the water supply and the environment. Soaring population and complex technology have greatly increased the societies' appetite for water. Even in parts of world that receive significant rainfall, people are using groundwater faster than it can be naturally replenished. We must face the reality that water is valuable, and is a finite resource. Greater conservation on the part of individuals, industry, and farming is the answer. Then there is the problem of water pollution affecting the health of the people. It is also part of development and population growth.

Clearing the Air

One of the unexpected consequences of industrial technology (especially the factory and the motor vehicle) has been a decline in air quality. In the developed countries, great strides have been made in combating pollution caused by industrial way of life. Laws have made to prohibit air pollution. Scientists have developed new technologies to reduce the air pollution. But in the developing countries the problem of air pollution is becoming serious. Fuels used for cooking and heating

damage the air quality. The poor nations are eager to encourage short-term industrial development but pay little heed to the long-term dangers of air pollution. Cities are plagued by air pollution. There is also the danger of acid rain. It refers to precipitation, made acidic by air pollution that destroys plant and animal life. It begins with power plants burning fossil fuels (oil and coal) to generate electricity; this burning releases sulfuric and nitrous oxides into the air. As the wind sweeps these gases into the atmosphere, they react with the air to form sulfuric and nitric acids, which turn atmospheric moisture acidic. One type of pollution can cause another. Air pollution can cause water contamination.

Preserving the Forests

Forests are falling victim to the needs and appetites of the surging world populations. Land is cleared of forests for using it for other purposes. Then we have the lumber industry, which eats the forests. Forests play an important part in cleansing the atmosphere of carbon dioxide (CO_2). With the depletion of forest, the process of cleaning the atmospheres is hampered. In the atmosphere, carbon dioxide behaves much like the glass roof of a greenhouse, letting heat from the sun pass through to the earth while preventing much of it radiating back away from the planet. Ecologists therefore speculate about a possible green-house effect, a rise in the earth's temperature due to an increasing concentration of carbon dioxide in the atmosphere. It will result in global warming. The warming trend will melt vast areas of the polar icecaps and raise the sea level to cover low lying land areas of the world. Though this issue has been a controversy, but certainly it has an effect on biodiversity. These forests are home to a variety of 30 million living species. What is the significance of this biodiversity? Biodiversity

is a rich source for human food, a vital genetic resource for research, provides beauty and complexity of environment, and the extinction of any species is irreversible and final.

Society and the environment

It is the operation of society that affects the natural environment. The values and beliefs to the operation of a social system are highly important. Therefore the state of the environment reflects our attitudes towards the natural world. As part of the logic of growth, environment has been used as a resource. Humans have also been trying to solve the environmental problems, and functionalists are optimistic that human beings can do it.

Social conflict theorists maintain that the problems of natural environment result from social arrangements favored by the elites. Elites directly or indirectly aggravate environmental problems as they advance their self-interest. There is also environment racism: the pattern by which environmental hazards are greatest in proximity to poor people, especially minorities. Environmental problems from the conflict point of view, result from a society's class structure and, globally, the world's hierarchy of nations. It has been that the high-income countries place the greatest demand on the natural environment. Environmental problems are likely to grow worse as in poor societies as they develop economically, using more resources and producing more waste and pollution in the process. In the long run, all nations of the world share a vital interest in protecting the national environment.

Sustainable Society and World

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Solution to the entire range of environmental problems is for all of us to live in a way that does not add to the environmental deficit. We have to look for ecologically sustainable culture, which refers to way of life that meets the needs of the present generation without threatening the environmental legacy of future generations. Sustainable living calls for three basic goals.

1. The first is the conservation of the finite resources, that is, satisfying our present wants with a responsible eye toward the future. Conservation involves using resources more efficiently, seeking alternative sources of energy, and, in some cases, learning to live with less.
2. The second goal is reducing waste. Whenever possible, simply using less is the most effective way to reduce waste. In addition, societies around the world need to recycling programs. Success depends upon educating the people to reduce waste and passing laws that require recycling of certain materials.
3. The third goal in any plan for sustainable ecosystem must be to bring world popular action growth under-control.

But even sweeping environmental strategies – put in place with the best intentions - - will fail without some fundamental changes in how we think about ourselves and our world. We need to realize that the present is tied to the future. Simply put, today's actions shape tomorrow's world. Second, rather than viewing humans as "different" from other forms of life and assuming that we have the right to dominate the planet, we must acknowledge that all forms of life are interdependent. Thirdly, achieving a sustainable ecosystem requires global cooperation.

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LESSON 43

SOCIAL CHANGE

Change is difference between two points in time. What was at time one and what it is at time two. The difference between two points in time can be called as change.

Time 2 – Time 1 = Difference i.e. change

Social change means the changes in the social structure and social relationships. At macro level we can look at social change at the societal level just like the changes in the population structure of the country. One could look at age structure of the population. As we have already discussed this structure like 43 percent of the population of Pakistan is that of children, about 4 percent is that of old people and the rest may be adults. Then you can also look at the rural and urban distribution of people. Educational distribution of people is another angle of population structure; there is lot of shifting from rural to urban areas. One could also look at changing birth rate as an aspect of social change. At the micro level one could also look at the changes taking place in the structure of families in terms of size, authority structure, age at marriage, number of children per woman. There can be change in the relationships of people. For example there is decline in the neighborliness, there are changes in the employer and employee relationships, there is change in the men and women relationships (women empowerment), and so on.

Similar to social change there is another concept of cultural change, which means changes in the culture of society. This change could be seen in the patterns of behavior of people (norm), in the laws of

society, in the technology of the society. Social change and cultural change overlap and sometimes it become difficult to make a distinction between social change and cultural change. Therefore to overcome such an ambiguous situation the two concepts are combined and called as socio-cultural change.

Social change usually does not appear suddenly unless there is some natural catastrophe. It is usually a continuous process. The process of social change has four major characteristics.

1. Social change happens all the time. Nothing is constant and change is inevitable. The process of change may be slow at one time than another time. One society may be changing faster than the other. Hunting and food gathering societies have been changing quite slowly; members of today's high income societies on the other hand, experience significant change within a single lifetime. Some elements of culture change faster than the others. The gap between the two has been referred as cultural lag. The concept of cultural lag was given by W. F. Ogburn. This concept may be defined as: when two interrelated parts of culture change at different rate so that one moves faster than the other whereby one is left behind, the gap between the two is called cultural lag. Within the culture, material culture usually changes faster than the non-material culture (ideas, attitudes).
2. Social change is sometimes intentional but often unplanned. Industrial societies actively encourage many kinds of change. For example, scientists seek more efficient forms of energy, and advertisers try to convince us that life is incomplete without this or that new gadget. So market researchers find out new ways of convincing people to use the new product. Yet rarely one can

envision all the consequences of the changes that are set in motion. Automobile has been introduced for mobility and transportation. At the same time there have appeared many unintended consequences like pollution, accidents, and the same autos being used for robbery and other unlawful activities.

3. Social change is controversial. Social change brings both good and bad consequences. Capitalists welcomed the industrial revolution because new technology increased productivity and increased profits. However, the workers feared that the machines would make their skills outdated and resisted the push for progress. Look at women empowerment; for some it could be a sign of progress while others may consider it as a sign of decline.

Some changes matter more than others. Some changes (such as clothing fads) have only passing significance, whereas others (like computers) last a long time and may change the entire world. Information technology may revolutionize the whole world just like the industrial revolution.

LESSON 44

CAUSES OF SOCIAL CHANGE

Culture and Change

There are three important sources of cultural change:

- Invention
- Discovery
- Diffusion.

Invention is the combination of existing elements of culture into something new. Inventions produce new objects, ideas, and social patterns. Invention of ideas, objects and social patterns bring social change.

Discovery occurs when people take note of existing elements of the world. Medical advances, for example, offer a growing understanding of the human body. Human body has been there but perhaps in the olden times humans did not know much about its functioning and dis-functioning. Discoveries about the functioning of human body have added to the scientific knowledge. Beyond the direct effects on human health, medical discoveries have stretched life expectancy. Increase in life expectancy is change in society.

Diffusion is the transference of cultural traits from place and/or group to another. Diffusion creates change as products, people, and information spread from one culture to another. Many of the familiar elements of culture may have come from other cultures. For purposes of diffusion to take place, it is necessary to have contact between two cultures. In the past contact used to be physical contact through

whatever means i.e. exchange of visits of people belonging to different cultures; one way visit of travelers, traders; conquerors who may invade, plunder, and leave with booty; other invaders who conquer and stay as rulers; colonizers who rule their colonies. All these situations demonstrate diffusion situations where the establishment of contact leads to borrowing of cultural traits from each other. The invaders and colonizers may bring their own culture and impose it on the local people. Nevertheless, these very rulers may have picked up some elements from the local culture. In the present times, for purposes of diffusion, the two different societies don't have to have a physical contact with each other. Presently mass media of communication has demolished the physical boundaries for contacting other cultures. Now perhaps you have to have a control over the "mouse" and reach anywhere in the world, know about its culture, understand it, and if like may borrow its cultural traits. Look at borrowing of fashions from outside, mixing of cultures, and exchange of communication across the cultures.

Conflict and Change

Tension and conflict in a society also produce change. Karl Marx saw class conflict as the engine that drives societies from one historical era to another. Social class has been considered by Marx as a means to social change. The two classes identified were the capitalists and the workers. Both these classes are based on inequality (We have already discussed it under "social stratification"). Social classes are located in the different relationships of people to the means of production. The relationships become important if a group becomes conscious and organized for action. Out of these two groups capitalists oppose social change, whereas the workers want to change the society. According to

Marx the conflict between the two classes is a means to social change. The two classes cannot remain in conflict for all the time. The conflicting situation has to be resolved, and whatever the 'give and take' for resolving the conflict, the new situation will be different from the previous one a social change new relationships.

In more than a century since Marx' death this model has proven simplistic. Yet Marx correctly foresaw that social conflict arising from inequality (involving not just class but also race and gender) would force changes in every society.

Ideas and Change

For Karl Marx the most important aspect of human beings social life is the material basis of that life. In this approach society where private property is the source of material production there exists a basis of social conflict -- which in turn will lead to social change. Max Weber considered Marx's view just one perspective. There could be other explanations of social change. So instead of economic determinism, according to Weber, ideas could also determine economic structure. Weber traced the roots of social change to ideas. For example, people with charisma can carry a message that sometimes changes the world. Look at the prophets who have changed the societies with new ideas. The religious ideas turned into movements which changed the societies. Changes brought by Islam and its ideas brought drastic changes in the structure of society and relationships among the people. Weber also highlighted the importance of ideas by showing how the religious beliefs of early Protestants set the stage for the spread of industrial capitalism. The fact that industrial capitalism developed

primarily in areas of Western Europe where Protestant work ethic was strong proved to Weber the power of ideas to bring about change.

Ideas also generate social movements. For example we come across movements for bringing change in the ideas of people like social movements against “big dams” as part of environmentalism. There are movements for improving the lives of poor. There are movements for the rights of women.

Demographic Change

Population patterns also play a part in social change. There could be change in the structure of population with respect of age, education, occupation, etc. Pakistani population is experiencing all these changes. Migration within and among societies is a demographic factor that promotes change. In Pakistan there is a lot of migration from rural to urban areas. The urban population has increased from 20 percent in 1947 to 33 percent in 1998. The size of the urban settlements has increased putting pressure on the local resources, and other relationships. With the change in education of women, female participation in the labor force is on the increase which has implications for the institution of family.

Environmental Changes

Environmental change can bring changes in the structure of societies and relationship of people. Degradation of the environment may force people to migrate to new places. Water logging and salinity of agricultural land makes people to migrate simply because they have lost their means of livelihood. Similarly people leave their settlements due to drought. Environmental changes brought about by

"development projects" can also be a factor for social change. For the construction of water reservoirs, motor ways, and industrial zones may necessitate the displacement of populations. The same populations may get training for new jobs and follow new occupations. It may change the life styles of the whole communities. Similarly the natural calamities can destroy the human settlements as well as their means of livelihood, and thereby could be a factor of social change. People may change their occupations, develop new settlements, migrate to new areas; all these situations are situations of social changes.

LESSON 45
MODERNITY AND POST MODERNITY

Modernization

Modernization is process of social change initiated by industrialization in the mid18th century. Modernization is the process of the adoption of those patterns of behavior which have been considered as modern.

The rise of modernity is a complex process involving many dimensions of change. These dimensions could be: cultural patterns, social structure, social institutions, and social change. As a result of modernization:

- There is decline of small and traditional communities. In the traditional societies there is lot of cohesiveness, strong sense of belongingness, strong neighborhood relations but all these undergo change as the communities become complex in an industrial society. The structure and relations in the families also undergo change in the modern society.
- There is an expansion of personal choice in the modern society. Personal choices increase for getting education, for choosing an occupation, for a place to live, for choosing a spouse, and even

for adopting a lifestyle. There are series of options provided by the modern society and one could choose. Such options were not available in the traditional society.

- There is an increasing diversity in the society. In the urban areas one could see the diversity of people, diversity of occupations, diversity of religions, diversity of races, diversity of ethnic groups, diversity of lifestyles, diversity of economic systems, diversity of political lines, and so on. Such diversities provide rich resources for interactions and changes in society.
- There is future orientation and growing awareness of time. People in the modern societies think more about the future. Being optimistic they try to improve their lives by adopting innovations rather than having emotional attachment with traditions. These people are time conscious and organize their daily routines down to the very minute. All the causes of social change have interconnections and overlap each other.

Modernity

Modernity means the adoption of those social patterns that have resulted from industrialization. In everyday usage modernity designates the present in relation to the past. Sociologists include in this concept the social patterns set in motion by the Industrial Revolution beginning in Western Europe in the middle of 18th century.

Cultural Patterns

1. Heterogeneous values because people of different religion and cultural norms are living together
2. High tolerance of diversity of norms is seen in the modern society
3. Now a day's people are more conscious about the time and their future.
4. High technology and advance energy resources

Social Structure

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1. In the modern society there is a variety of occupations as well as variety of statuses and the corresponding roles to be performed. Most of the statuses as well as roles are achieved ones.
2. The modern societies, people are more concerned about their own affairs. They have secondary relations and don't know much about what is happening in the neighborhood
3. Due to the diversities of culture in the modern society, the cultural norms may conflict with each other. Therefore, the whole system gets formalized and enforced by agencies authorized by the law of the country.
4. Modern societies exhibit fluid patterns of social inequality. Status of a person is an achieved one and there are plenty of opportunities to move from one occupation to another. In modern industrial societies there is lot of social mobility.
5. Societies move toward universal education and women start participating in the labor force. As a result they become financially independent and fight for their rights. Hence the decision making becomes fluid, moving away from authoritarian pattern to egalitarian pattern. All this change, amounts to women empowerment.
6. In modern society, power resides in large bureaucracies' leaving people in local communities little control over their lives.
7. Nuclear families are in trend
8. In the modern societies, religion weakens with the rise of science. People look for the solution of their problems in science rather than in religion.
9. In the modern society basic schooling becomes universal, with growing proportion of population receiving advanced education
10. Comparatively in the modern societies there is low birth rate and low death rate. Due to high standard of living and sophisticated technology people usually enjoy longer life expectancy.
11. Settlement patterns in the modern societies are large. Population is typically concentrated in large cities.
12. In the modern societies change is very rapid and it is evident within a single generation.

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Post-modernity

Post-modern society is another term for postindustrial society; its chief characteristic is the use of tools that extend the human abilities to gather and analyze information, to communicate, and to travel.

Characteristics of Post-Modern Society

In 1973, Daniel Bell noted the emergence of a *postindustrial society*. He gave six characteristics:

1. Extensive travel among nations;
2. A vast surplus of goods;
3. A service sector so large that it employs the majority of workers;
4. A wide variety and quantity of goods available to average person;
5. An 'information explosion'
6. A 'global village' i.e. instantaneous, worldwide communications.

Post-industrial society remains a matter of debate

Five basic themes of this debate:

1. In important respects, modernity has failed: The promise of modern society was a life free from want. As postmodernist critics see it, however, the twentieth century was unsuccessful in solving social problems like poverty, since many people still lack financial security.

2. The bright light of "progress" is fading. Modern people look to the future, expecting their lives will improve in significant ways. Members of post-modern societies, however, are less confident about what the future holds. Optimism has been replaced with pessimism with the assumption that the life is getting worse.

3. Science no longer holds the answers. The defining trait of the modern era was a scientific outlook and a confident belief that technology would make life better. But post-modern critics contend that science has not solved many old problems (like the poor health) and has even created new problems (such as degrading the environments). Science has been widely used for political purposes, especially by powerful segments of society.

4. Cultural debates are intensifying. Modernity was to be an era of enhanced individuality and expanding tolerance. But it has fallen short here as well. Feminism points out that patriarchy still continues to limit the lives of women, and multiculturalism seeks to empower minorities who still remain at the margin of social life. Moreover, now that more people have all the material things they need, ideas are taking on more importance. Thus, post-modernity is also a post-materialistic era, in which issues like social justice, as well as the environment and gay rights, command more and more attention.

5. Social institutions are changing. Just as industrialization brought a sweeping transformation to social institutions, the rise of a post-industrial society is remaking society all over again. Just as the Industrial Revolution placed *material things* at the center of productive life, now the Information Revolution emphasizes *ideas.* Similarly, the post-modern family no longer conforms to any single pattern; on the contrary, individuals are choosing among many new family forms. There are diversities in the marriage and family.

Despite such debate, yet few think that modernity has failed completely; after all, we have seen marked increases in longevity and living standards over the course of last century. Moreover, even if we accept post-modernist views that science is bankrupt and progress is a sham, what are the alternatives?

But as part of global stratification, poor societies appear to have little ability to modernize. Here the barrier does not appear to be the ‘traditionalism’ but global domination by the rich capitalist societies. The rich nations only perpetuate current patterns of global inequality.

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THE END

GOOD LUCK